Chapter 13 — Classic Concurrency Problems · Study Edition

> **Study edition.** All 11 problems with their core solution code, padding removed. Demo `main` methods, helpers and full outputs are in the Full Edition (`README.md`).
>
> **Goal.** Chapter 12 gave you the toolbox; this chapter uses it on the problems interviewers ask — LeetCode's concurrency set (FooBar, Zero-Even-Odd, FizzBuzz, H2O, Dining Philosophers) and "design a thread-safe X" rounds (TTL cache, concurrent hash map, blocking queue, Bloom filter, parallel merge sort, rate limiter).

Layout per problem: *Problem → Approach → Java solution → Why it's correct → Pitfalls → Real-world examples → In the interview → Self-check → TL;DR.* Code: Java 21 in `code/lld/ch13/<problem>/Main.java`. Where event order varies, demos *verify* the result and print `true/false`.

```
javac --release 21 -d /tmp/lld_13 $(find . -name '*.java')
java -cp /tmp/lld_13 lld.ch13.foobar.Main
```

Problem map — which tool solves what

#	Problem	Core idea	Main tools
13.1	Print FooBar Alternately	Pass a "baton" between 2 threads	`Semaphore` ×2 (or monitor + turn flag)
13.2	Print Zero Even Odd	A dispatcher thread decides who goes next	`Semaphore` ×3
13.3	Fizz Buzz Multithreaded	4 threads, one counter, each waits for "its" numbers	`synchronized` + `wait/notifyAll`
13.4	Building H2O	Group threads into 2 H + 1 O	`Semaphore` (slots) + `CyclicBarrier`
13.5	Dining Philosophers	Avoid deadlock over shared forks	Lock ordering, or a "waiter" semaphore
13.6	Thread-safe cache with TTL	Expiring entries, no stampede	`ConcurrentHashMap`, `compute`, scheduled sweeper
13.7	Concurrent HashMap (simplified)	Lock striping	`ReentrantLock[]`, all-stripe resize
13.8	Bounded Blocking Queue	Wait when full / empty	`wait/notifyAll` **and** `Lock` + 2 `Condition`s
13.9	Concurrent Bloom Filter	Lock-free bit set	`AtomicLongArray` + atomic OR
13.10	Multi-threaded Merge Sort	Divide and conquer on cores	`ForkJoinPool`, `RecursiveAction`
13.11	Rate limiter (token bucket)	Atomic refill-and-take	`synchronized`, or CAS on immutable state

Checklist for any concurrency problem: (1) What is the **shared state**? (2) What **ordering or invariant** must hold? (3) Who **waits**, for **what**, and who **signals**? (4) Pick the primitive: turn-taking → semaphores; "wait until predicate" → condition variable; groups → barrier; mutual exclusion → lock; one variable → atomic. (5) Check **liveness**: can anyone wait forever, does every thread exit?

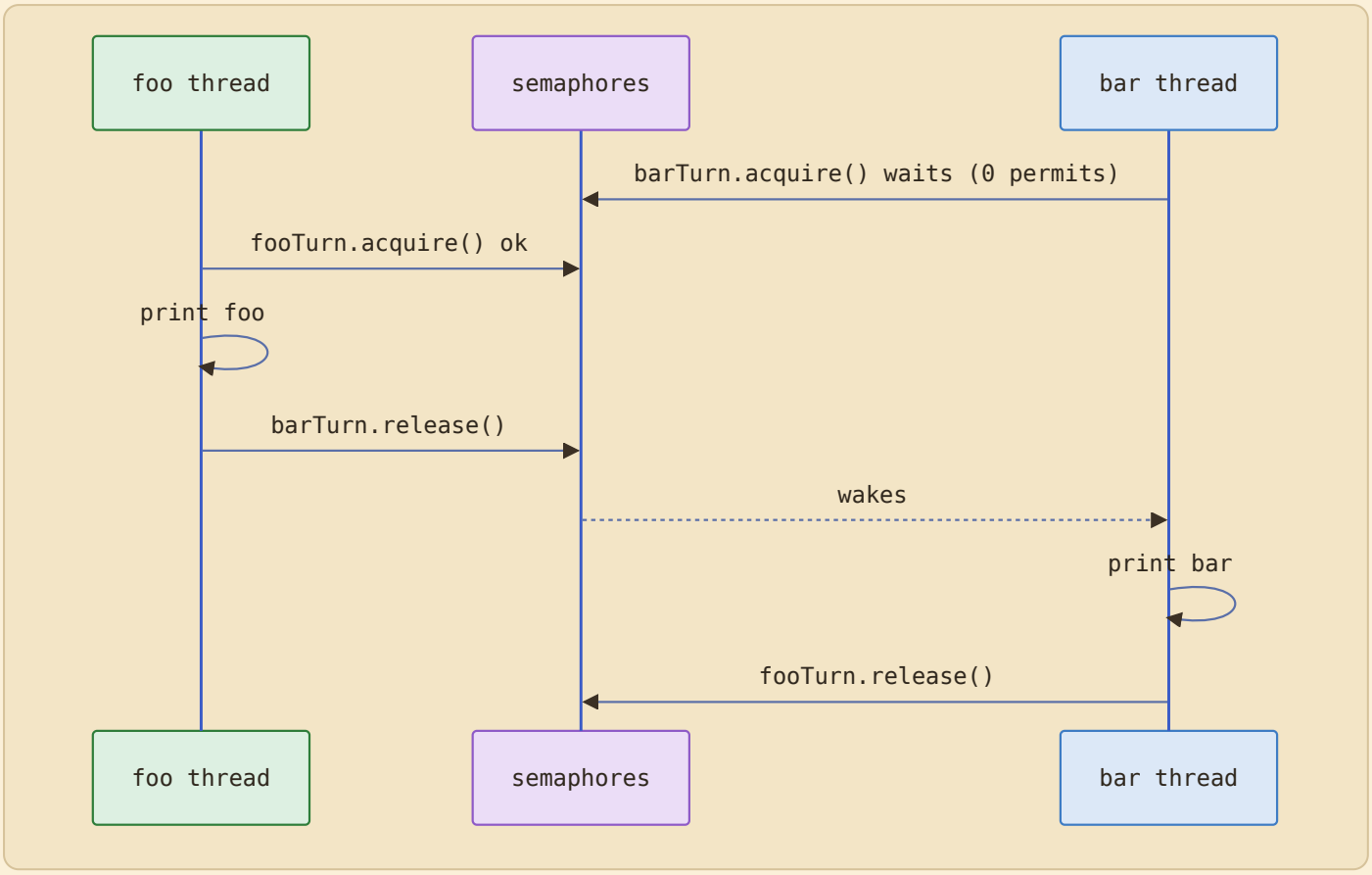
13.1 Print FooBar Alternately (LeetCode 1115)

Problem

Thread A calls `foo()` (prints "foo" *n* times), thread B calls `bar()` (prints "bar" *n* times). Output must be "foobar" × *n*, whichever starts first.

Approach

Pure **signaling** (12.20) — a baton: `fooTurn = Semaphore(1)`, `barTurn = Semaphore(0)`; each thread acquires its own, prints, releases the other's. Alternative: a monitor with a `fooTurn` flag, `while (!fooTurn) wait();`, flip, `notifyAll()`.



Java solution

```java
// File: code/lld/ch13/foobar/Main.java
    /** Solution 1: two semaphores used as a baton that is passed back and forth. */
    static class FooBarSemaphore {
        private final int n;
        private final Semaphore fooTurn = new Semaphore(1);   // foo may go first
        private final Semaphore barTurn = new Semaphore(0);   // bar must wait

        FooBarSemaphore(int n) { this.n = n; }

        void foo(Runnable printFoo) throws InterruptedException {
            for (int i = 0; i < n; i++) {
                fooTurn.acquire();       // wait for my turn
                printFoo.run();
                barTurn.release();       // hand the baton to bar
            }
        }
        void bar(Runnable printBar) throws InterruptedException {
            for (int i = 0; i < n; i++) {
                barTurn.acquire();
                printBar.run();
                fooTurn.release();
            }
        }
    }
    // ... Solution 2 (FooBarMonitor): synchronized + while (!fooTurn) wait(); flip; notifyAll()
```

Output (bar thread started first on purpose): `semaphores : foobarfoobarfoobarfoobar`, `both correct: true`. Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/foobar/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Invariant: the two semaphores hold exactly 1 permit in total, so turns strictly alternate; `release()` happens-before the `acquire()` it enables; matched loops terminate.

Pitfalls

One shared semaphore (a thread re-takes its own release); `if` instead of `while`; busy-waiting on a `volatile` flag.

Real-world examples

Ping-pong protocols, request/acknowledge stages, double-buffering.

In the interview

30-second answer: "Two semaphores as a baton: foo's starts at 1, bar's at 0. Each thread acquires its own, prints, and releases the other's. The total permits are always one, so they alternate."

Self-check

- **Q:** What if `barTurn` starts at 1? **A:** bar may print first.

TL;DR

Two semaphores, one permit total, passed back and forth.

13.2 Print Zero Even Odd (LeetCode 1116)

Problem

Three threads: `zero()` prints only 0, `even()` only evens, `odd()` only odds; together `0 1 0 2 … 0 n` (n = 5 → `0102030405`).

Approach

The zero thread is a **dispatcher**: after the 0 for position *i* it releases `oddTurn` (odd *i*) or `evenTurn`; they print and release `zeroTurn`. Initial permits: zero 1, odd 0, even 0.

Java solution

```java
// File: code/lld/ch13/zeroevenodd/Main.java
        private final Semaphore zeroTurn = new Semaphore(1);
        private final Semaphore oddTurn = new Semaphore(0);
        private final Semaphore evenTurn = new Semaphore(0);
        // ...
        void zero(IntConsumer print) throws InterruptedException {
            for (int i = 1; i <= n; i++) {
                zeroTurn.acquire();
                print.accept(0);
                // The zero thread is the "dispatcher": it decides who prints next.
                if (i % 2 == 1) oddTurn.release(); else evenTurn.release();
            }
        }
        void odd(IntConsumer print) throws InterruptedException {
            for (int i = 1; i <= n; i += 2) {
                oddTurn.acquire();
                print.accept(i);
                zeroTurn.release();
            }
        }
        // ... even() is the same loop from 2 with evenTurn
```

Output: `n=5 -> 0102030405`, `n=10 -> 0102030405060708090 10`. Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/zeroevenodd/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

One permit in the system → one printer at a time; loop counts match permits (zero *n*, odd ⌈n/2⌉, even ⌊n/2⌋), so everyone exits.

Pitfalls

Unsynchronized shared counters; loop bounds that don't match permits (a thread hangs).

Real-world examples

Dispatcher/worker designs (opcode routing, alternating schedulers).

In the interview

30-second answer: "Three semaphores. Zero starts with one permit. After each 0 it releases odd or even depending on the index, and they release zero back. One permit total in the system, so the order is forced."

> **Self-check**

- **Q:** For n = 4, how many times does `odd()` acquire? **A:** Twice (1 and 3).

> **TL;DR**

Zero is the dispatcher; one permit circulates among three semaphores.

13.3 Fizz Buzz Multithreaded (LeetCode 1195)

Problem

Four threads output 1..n: multiples of 15 → `fizzbuzz`, of 3 only → `fizz`, of 5 only → `buzz`, else the number — each kind printed by its own thread.

Approach

One shared `current` guarded by the monitor; each thread loops with its own predicate: `while (current <= n && !mine(current)) wait();`, exit (with `notifyAll()`) if `current > n`, else print, `current++`, `notifyAll()`. The **condition-variable** pattern (12.13); `runWhile(predicate, action)` avoids writing the loop four times.

Java solution

```java
// File: code/lld/ch13/fizzbuzz/Main.java
        private int current = 1;                                // guarded by 'this'
        // ...
        /** Shared loop: wait until 'current' is mine (or we're done), act, advance, wake everyone. */
        private void runWhile(IntPredicate mine, IntConsumer action) throws InterruptedException {
            while (true) {
                synchronized (this) {
                    while (current <= n && !mine.test(current)) wait();
                    if (current > n) { notifyAll(); return; }     // done: wake others so they can exit too
                    action.accept(current);
                    current++;
                    notifyAll();                                  // the next number may belong to anyone
                }
            }
        }

        void fizz(Runnable printFizz) throws InterruptedException {
            runWhile(i -> i % 3 == 0 && i % 5 != 0, i -> printFizz.run());
        }
        // ... buzz: i % 5 == 0 && i % 3 != 0; fizzbuzz: i % 15 == 0; number: neither
```

Output: `1, 2, fizz, 4, buzz, fizz, 7, 8, fizz, buzz, 11, fizz, 13, 14, fizzbuzz`. Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/fizzbuzz/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Predicates **partition** 1..n; `current` is only touched under the monitor; `notifyAll()` is required because four predicates share one wait set; the final `notifyAll` lets everyone see `current > n` and exit.

Pitfalls

`notify()` (lost wake-ups); no `current > n` exit check; overlapping predicates (two threads claim 15).

Real-world examples

Pipeline stages waiting for a job to reach their stage.

In the interview

> **30-second answer:** "One monitor, one shared counter. Each thread waits in a while loop until the counter matches its predicate or passes n, prints, increments and notifies all. The predicates partition the numbers, so exactly one thread acts per number."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why `notifyAll`? **A:** Threads wait for *different* conditions on one monitor; only waking all guarantees the right one wakes.

TL;DR

Shared counter + per-thread predicate + `while`-wait + `notifyAll`.

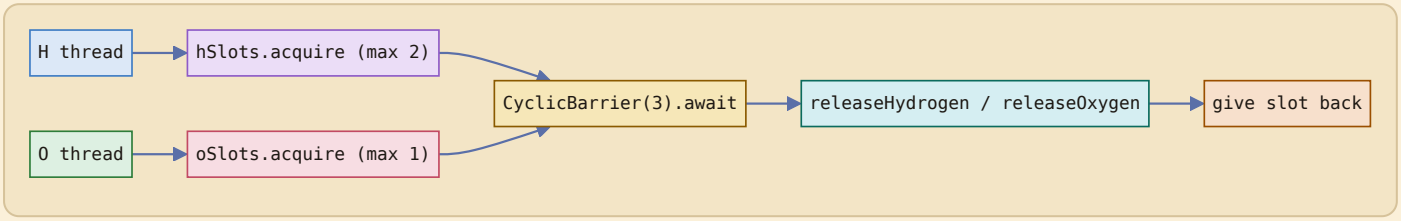
13.4 Building H2O (LeetCode 1117)

Problem

H and O threads arrive in any order and must leave in groups of exactly **2 H + 1 O**; one molecule's threads all pass before the next molecule's.

Approach

Slots — `hSlots = Semaphore(2)`, `oSlots = Semaphore(1)` cap the current molecule. **Group** — `CyclicBarrier(3)` makes the three atoms wait for each other. A thread returns its slot **after** it has been released, so the next molecule forms only when this one is done.



Java solution

```java
// File: code/lld/ch13/h2o/Main.java
    static class H2O {
        private final Semaphore hSlots = new Semaphore(2);    // at most 2 H in the current molecule
        private final Semaphore oSlots = new Semaphore(1);    // at most 1 O in the current molecule
        private final CyclicBarrier bond = new CyclicBarrier(3);   // wait until all 3 atoms are
present

        void hydrogen(Runnable releaseHydrogen) throws InterruptedException {
            hSlots.acquire();
            try {
                bond.await();
            } catch (BrokenBarrierException e) { throw new IllegalStateException(e); }
            releaseHydrogen.run();
            hSlots.release();                                 // free my slot only after I have "left"
        }
        // ... oxygen() is identical with oSlots
    }
```

Output: `molecules formed: 8, every group of 3 has 2 H + 1 O: true` (orders `HHO`, `HOH`, `OHH` are all valid, so the demo verifies instead of printing). Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/h2o/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Slots admit ≤2 H and ≤1 O per round and the barrier needs 3 → each trip is H, H, O; slots are freed only after printing, so groups never mix; the barrier resets itself.

Pitfalls

Releasing the slot **before** printing; no barrier; H:O not exactly 2:1 (last threads hang).

Real-world examples

Batching N items of given types (matchmaking, order assembly).

In the interview

30-second answer: "Two semaphores cap the molecule at 2 H and 1 O; a CyclicBarrier of 3 makes the three wait for each other; each atom returns its slot only after it's released, so molecules never interleave."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why is `hSlots` 2, not 1? **A:** A molecule needs two hydrogens inside the barrier at once.

TL;DR

Slots decide *who* can join; the barrier decides *when* they leave; free slots only after leaving.

13.5 Dining Philosophers (LeetCode 1226)

Problem

Five philosophers, five forks, each needs **both** adjacent forks. If everyone takes the left fork first, all may wait forever for the right — **deadlock** (all four Coffman conditions, 12.17).

Approach

Break **circular wait**: (1) **resource ordering** — always take the **lower-numbered** fork first (philosopher 4 takes fork 0 first); (2) **waiter** — a **fair** semaphore lets at most **n − 1** try at once, so someone always gets both forks. (Also: `tryLock` both with random back-off; Chandy–Misra for distributed settings.)

Java solution

```
// File: code/lld/ch13/philosophers/Main.java
    /** Fix 1 - resource ordering: always pick up the LOWER-numbered fork first (breaks circular
wait). */
    static class OrderedForks implements Table {
        private final ReentrantLock[] forks;
        // ... constructor creates n ReentrantLocks

        public void eat(int p, Runnable eatAction) {
            int left = p, right = (p + 1) % forks.length;
            ReentrantLock first = forks[Math.min(left, right)], second = forks[Math.max(left, right)];
            first.lock();
            try {
                second.lock();
                try { eatAction.run(); } finally { second.unlock(); }
            } finally { first.unlock(); }
        }
    }

    /** Fix 2 - a "waiter" lets at most n-1 philosophers try at once (breaks circular wait too). */
    static class Waiter implements Table {
        // ... forks as above, plus:
            seats = new Semaphore(n - 1, true);                // fair: nobody starves waiting for a
seat
        // ... eat(): seats.acquire(); lock left, then right; eat; unlock both; seats.release() in
finally
    }
```

Output: both strategies finish `[10000, 10000, 10000, 10000, 10000]` meals. Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/philosophers/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Ordering: increasing-index acquisition makes a waiting cycle impossible. **Waiter:** 4 diners, 5 forks → by pigeonhole someone eats. Forks are released in `finally`.

Pitfalls

Left-then-right for all (deadlock); `tryLock` retries without random back-off (livelock); the fair semaphore only makes *seats* FIFO — fair fork locks are needed for strict no-starvation.

Real-world examples

Anything needing two locks: bank transfers, multi-row DB transactions.

In the interview

30-second answer: "Naively everyone takes the left fork and waits for the right — circular wait, deadlock. I break circular wait by always taking the lower-numbered fork first, or by a waiter semaphore allowing only n−1 philosophers to try; fairness prevents starvation."

Self-check

- **Q:** With ordering, who behaves "differently"? **A:** The philosopher between forks 4 and 0 — takes fork 0 (right) first.

TL;DR

Break circular wait: global fork order, or only n−1 diners.

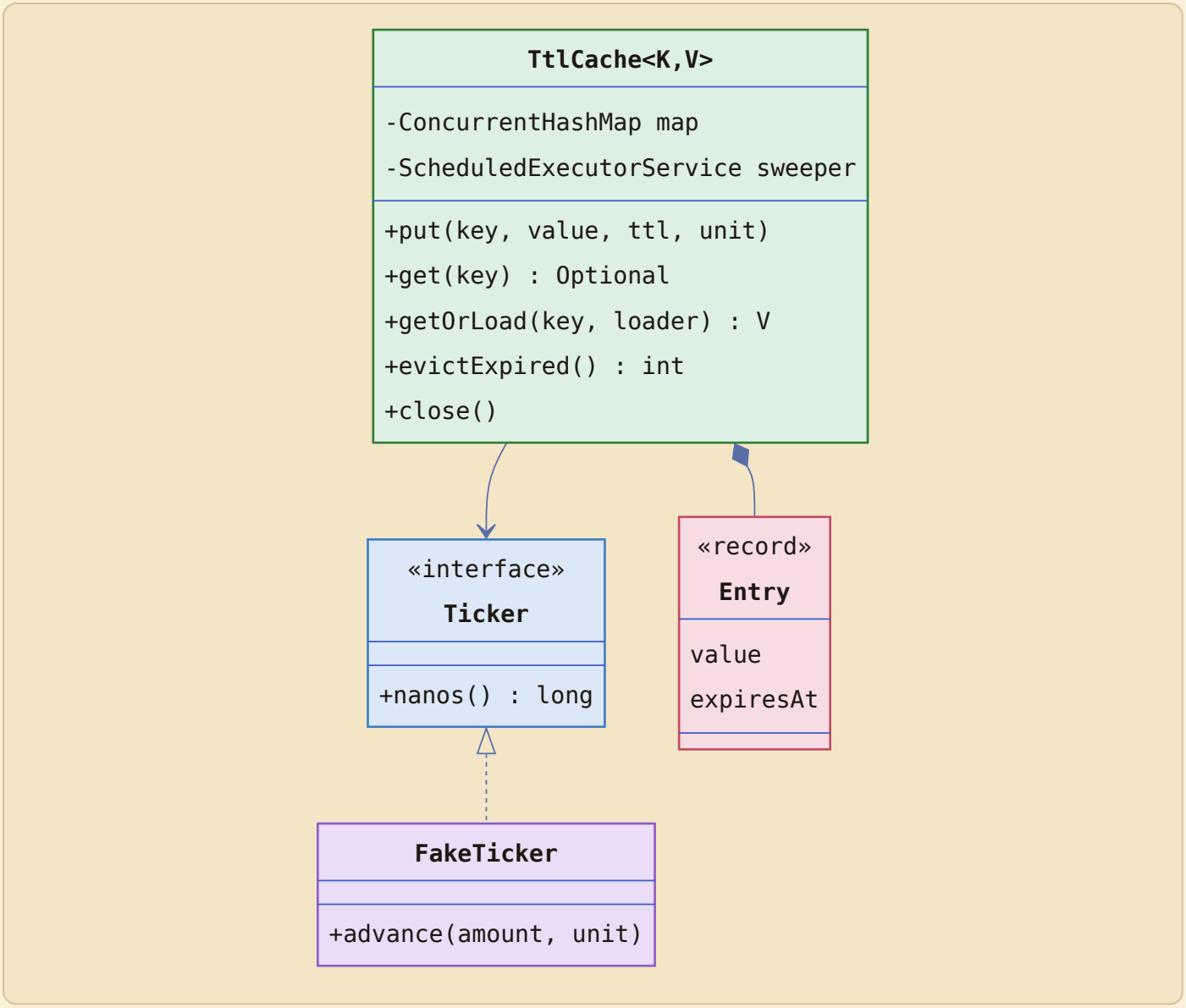
13.6 Thread-safe cache with TTL

Problem

A shared cache whose entries expire after a **TTL**: `put` (default or per-entry TTL), `get` hides expired entries, `getOrLoad` loads a miss **without a cache stampede**, expired entries leave memory, testable without sleeping.

Approach

Immutable `Entry(value, expiresAt)` in a `ConcurrentHashMap`; **lazy expiry** in `get` via conditional `remove(key, entry)`; **active expiry** by a daemon scheduled sweeper; **no stampede** via `map.compute` (loader runs once per key); an injected `Ticker` for tests.



Java solution

```
// File: code/lld/ch13/ttlcache/Main.java
        private record Entry<V>(V value, long expiresAt) { }

        private final ConcurrentHashMap<K, Entry<V>> map = new ConcurrentHashMap<>();
        // ... defaultTtlNanos, ticker, daemon sweeper scheduled at a fixed rate to call
evictExpired()

        private boolean expired(Entry<V> e) { return ticker.nanos() - e.expiresAt() >= 0; }   //
overflow-safe compare

        Optional<V> get(K key) {
            Entry<V> e = map.get(key);
            if (e == null) return Optional.empty();
            if (expired(e)) {
                map.remove(key, e);   // conditional remove: never deletes a FRESH value another
thread just put
                return Optional.empty();
            }
            return Optional.of(e.value());
        }

        V getOrLoad(K key, Function<? super K, ? extends V> loader) {
            return map.compute(key, (k, old) ->
                    old != null && !expired(old) ? old : new Entry<>(loader.apply(k), ticker.nanos() +
defaultTtlNanos)
            ).value();
        }
        // ... evictExpired(): for each entry, if expired, map.remove(key, entry) — the same
conditional remove
```

Output: `16 concurrent misses -> loader ran 1 time(s), all got same value: true`; with the real clock the sweeper empties 1,000 entries within 200 ms.

Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/ttlcache/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Immutable entries in one CHM (never half-written); `remove(key, e)` removes only that exact entry; `compute` is atomic per key (one load); `now - expiresAt >= 0` survives `nanoTime` overflow; the sweeper is a daemon closed in `close()`. (Its constructor leaks `this` to the sweeper — safe only because fields are set and executor submission is a happens-before edge; prefer a static factory.)

Pitfalls

Wall-clock `currentTimeMillis()` (use `nanoTime`); slow loaders inside `compute` block the bin (store a `CompletableFuture`); lazy-only expiry leaks, active-only serves stale — use both; no size limit (add LRU/LFU).

Real-world examples

Caffeine (and Guava `CacheBuilder`); **Redis** `EXPIRE` (lazy + periodic); sessions, OTPs, seat holds.

In the interview

30-second answer: "A ConcurrentHashMap of immutable entries holding value and expiry time. Get checks expiry lazily and removes with a conditional remove; a daemon scheduled sweeper removes expired keys nobody reads. getOrLoad uses compute so concurrent misses load once. Time is injected for testing."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why `remove(key, e)` not `remove(key)`? **A:** So a value written between our read and remove isn't deleted.

TL;DR

CHM + immutable (value, expiry) entries; lazy + scheduled expiry; `compute` for single-flight loads; injected clock.

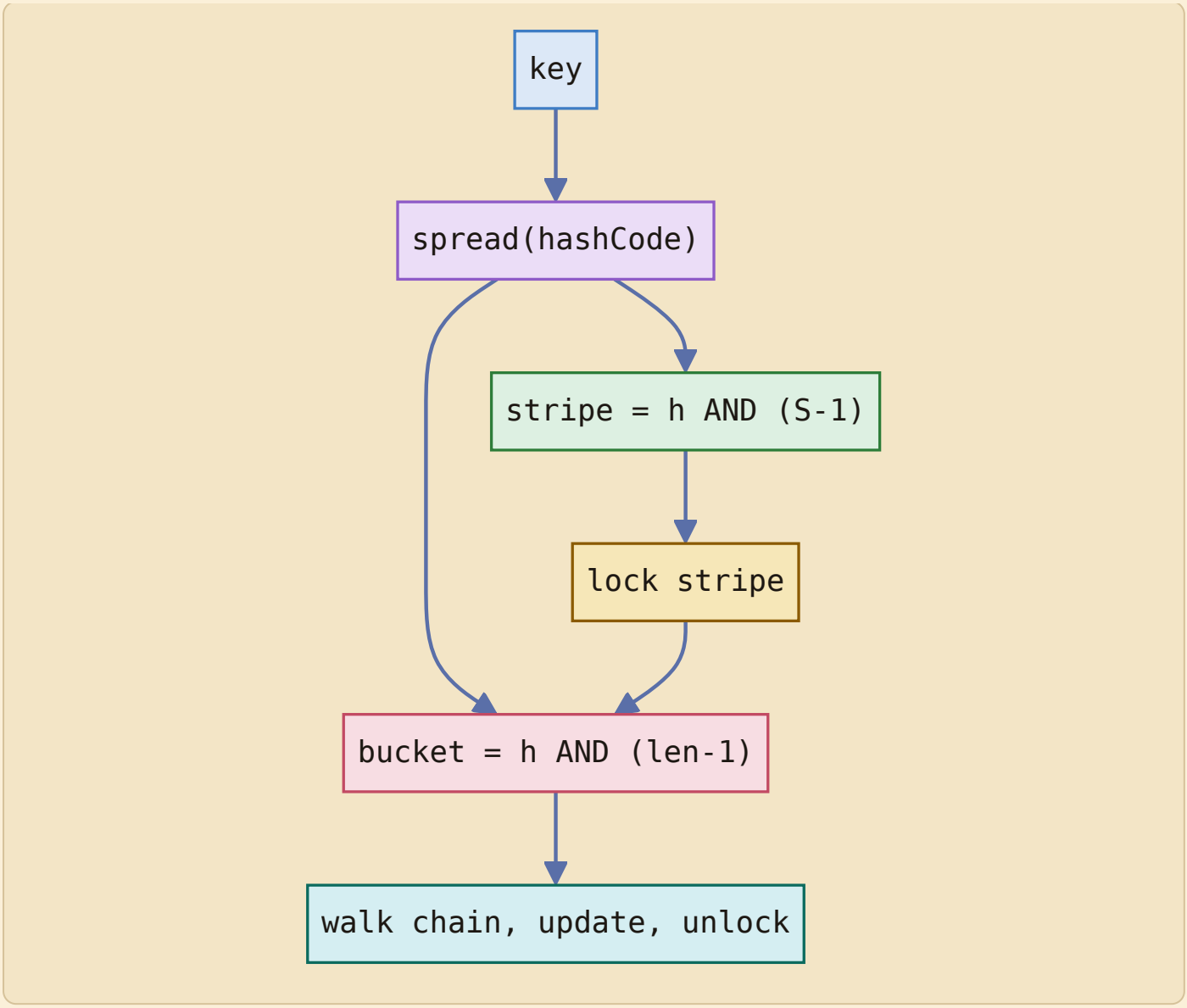
13.7 Design a (simplified) Concurrent HashMap — lock striping

Problem

A hash map with `get`, `put`, `remove`, `compute` and resizing, usable by many threads and faster than one global lock.

Approach

Lock striping (12.11): buckets of linked chains plus `S` locks (power of two). Key hash h → stripe `h & (S − 1)`, bucket `h & (len − 1)`; the stripe depends only on the hash, so it **never changes on resize**. Operations lock only their stripe. **Resize** (size > 0.75 × buckets): lock **all** stripes in index order, re-check, rehash into a 2× table, publish via `volatile`, unlock in reverse. Size in an `AtomicInteger`.


key
spread(hashCode)
stripe = h AND (S-1)
lock stripe
bucket = h AND (len-1)
walk chain, update, unlock

Java solution

```
// File: code/lld/ch13/stripedmap/Main.java
        private volatile Node<K, V>[] table;                // replaced (never mutated in place) only
while ALL locks are held
        private final ReentrantLock[] stripes;
        private final AtomicInteger size = new AtomicInteger();
        // ... constructor requires power-of-two sizes and stripes <= buckets

        // A key's stripe depends only on its hash, NOT on the table size, so it never changes on
resize.
        private ReentrantLock stripeFor(int hash) { return stripes[hash & (stripes.length - 1)]; }
        // ... get/remove: lock stripeFor(h), walk t[indexFor(h, t.length)], unlock
        // ... put/compute share doCompute(): under the stripe lock find the node, apply remap,
        // ... update / unlink / insert at head; then, AFTER unlocking:
            if (grew) resize();                                    // never resize while holding one
stripe

        /** Stop-the-world resize: take every stripe lock IN ORDER (no deadlock), rehash, publish. */
        private void resize() {
            for (ReentrantLock l : stripes) l.lock();
            try {
                Node<K, V>[] old = table;
                if (size.get() <= old.length * LOAD_FACTOR) return;  // another thread already resized
                Node<K, V>[] nt = (Node<K, V>[]) new Node[old.length * 2];
                // ... move every node to nt[indexFor(n.hash, nt.length)]
                table = nt;
            } finally {
                for (int i = stripes.length - 1; i >= 0; i--) stripes[i].unlock();
            }
        }
```

Output: 8 threads × 20,000 puts → `size=160000, missing=0`, table grew 16 → 262144 buckets; 80,000 concurrent `compute` increments are exact.

Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/stripedmap/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Each bucket has exactly one stripe (powers of two, $S \le$ length → stripe index = low bits of bucket index). **Resize** holds all locks, re-checks, publishes via `volatile`. **No deadlock:** one lock normally; resize takes all in order after releasing its own. **Compute** runs wholly under the stripe lock.

Pitfalls

Stripe from the current bucket index (changes on resize); resizing while holding a stripe; unsynchronized `table` reads; `null` keys/values.

How the real `ConcurrentHashMap` goes further

Aspect	This design	JDK 8+ `ConcurrentHashMap`
Reads	Lock the stripe	Lock-free (volatile reads)
Write locking	One of S stripe locks	CAS into empty bins; `synchronized` on the bin head otherwise
Long chains	Linked list	Red-black tree beyond 8 nodes (table ≥ 64)
Resize	Stop-the-world	Incremental; threads help transfer
Size	`AtomicInteger`	`LongAdder`-style counter cells

Real-world examples

Java 7's `ConcurrentHashMap` **segments** (16 by default); Guava `Striped<Lock>`; Caffeine's striped read buffers.

In the interview

> **30-second answer:** "An array of buckets plus a small array of locks; each key maps to a stripe by its hash bits, so different stripes work in parallel. Every bucket belongs to exactly one stripe. Resize takes all stripe locks in order, rehashes and publishes the new table through a volatile field."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why must the stripe count divide the table length? **A:** So every bucket maps to exactly one stripe.

TL;DR

N locks for M buckets, stripe by hash bits, resize under all locks in order, publish via volatile.

13.8 Thread-safe bounded Blocking Queue (two ways)

Problem

A fixed-capacity FIFO for producer-consumer: `put` blocks while full, `take` while empty, plus timed `offer(item, timeout)` and `poll(timeout)`.

Approach

A **circular array** (`head`, `tail`, `count`) and two synchronisation designs:

	Way 1: monitor	Way 2: `ReentrantLock` + 2 `Condition`s
Lock	`synchronized` methods	`lock.lockInterruptibly()`
Wait	`while (full) wait();`	`while (full) notFull.await();`
Wake	`notifyAll()` — one shared wait set	`notEmpty.signal()` / `notFull.signal()`
Timed wait	`TimeUnit.timedWait` + deadline loop	`awaitNanos` returns time left
Efficiency	Wakes everyone (thundering herd)	Wakes one thread of the right kind

Java solution

```java
// File: code/lld/ch13/blockingqueue/Main.java
    // ... Way 1 (MonitorQueue): producers AND consumers share one monitor, so notifyAll():
        public synchronized void put(T item) throws InterruptedException {
            while (count == items.length) wait();
            enqueue(item);
            notifyAll();
        }
    // ...
    // ... Way 2 (ConditionQueue): ReentrantLock with TWO condition queues (how ArrayBlockingQueue is
built).
        private final ReentrantLock lock = new ReentrantLock();
        private final Condition notFull = lock.newCondition();
        private final Condition notEmpty = lock.newCondition();

        public void put(T item) throws InterruptedException {
            if (item == null) throw new NullPointerException();
            lock.lockInterruptibly();
            try {
                while (count == items.length) notFull.await();
                enqueue(item);
            } finally { lock.unlock(); }
        }
        // ... take() mirrors put(); timed poll/offer loop on nanos = notEmpty.awaitNanos(nanos)
(returns time left)
        private void enqueue(T item) {
            items[tail] = item;
            tail = (tail + 1) % items.length;
            count++;
            notEmpty.signal();                                      // wake ONE waiting consumer
        }
        @SuppressWarnings("unchecked")
        private T dequeue() {
            T x = (T) items[head];
            items[head] = null;
            head = (head + 1) % items.length;
            count--;
            notFull.signal();                                       // wake ONE waiting producer
            return x;
        }
```

Both pass a stress test (3 producers × 20,000, 3 consumers, capacity 2): `consumed 60000 items, sum ok=true, left in queue=0`; `poll(30ms)` on empty → `null`, `offer(30ms)` on full → `false`. Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/blockingqueue/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

One lock guards all fields; `while` loops handle spurious wakeups; Way 1 needs `notifyAll()` (one shared wait set); Way 2 can `signal()` (separate queues per kind); timed waits track *remaining* time.

Pitfalls

`if` instead of `while`; `notify()` on a shared monitor; not nulling `items[head]` (leak); `null` items when `null` means timeout.

Real-world examples

`ArrayBlockingQueue` = Way 2; `LinkedBlockingQueue` uses **two** locks (`putLock`, `takeLock`).

In the interview

> **30-second answer:** "A circular array with head, tail and count guarded by one lock. put waits while count == capacity, take waits while count == 0, both in while loops. With synchronized I must use notifyAll because both sides share one wait set; with ReentrantLock I use two Conditions, notFull and notEmpty, and signal just the right side."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why is `signal()` safe in Way 2 but `notify()` unsafe in Way 1? **A:** Separate condition queues guarantee the woken thread is the right kind.

TL;DR

Circular buffer + one lock + wait-while-full/empty loops. Monitor → `notifyAll`; Lock → `notFull`/`notEmpty` + `signal`.

13.9 Concurrent Bloom Filter

Problem

A thread-safe **Bloom filter** — a compact probabilistic set answering *"definitely not present"* or *"probably present"* — that many threads add to and query at once.

Approach

m bits; **add** sets *k* hashed positions; **query**: any 0 → **definitely absent**, all 1 → **probably** present (*false positive* possible). No false negatives, no deletion (a *counting* filter allows it).

Sizing for *n* items and false-positive rate *p*: $m = \lceil -n \cdot \ln p / (\ln 2)^2 \rceil$, $k = \text{round}((m / n) \cdot \ln 2)$. For $n = 80{,}000$, $p = 1\%$ → $m \approx 766{,}805$ bits (≈ 93.6 KiB), $k = 7$ — about **9.6 bits per item**, whatever the item size.

Double hashing (Kirsch–Mitzenmacher): positions $h1 + i \cdot h2$. **Lock-free:** an `AtomicLongArray` with **atomic OR** (`getAndAccumulate`); queries are volatile reads — bits only go 0 → 1, so a query can at most miss an unfinished `add`.

Java solution

```
// File: code/lld/ch13/bloomfilter/Main.java
        private final AtomicLongArray words;     // m bits packed into 64-bit words
        // ... numBits (m) and numHashes (k) computed from expectedItems and falsePositiveRate

        /** Adds the item. Returns true if at least one bit changed (i.e. it was definitely new). */
        boolean add(String item) {
            long base = fnv1a64(item);
            long h1 = fmix64(base), h2 = fmix64(base ^ 0x9E3779B97F4A7C15L) | 1;   // h2 odd
            boolean changed = false;
            for (int i = 0; i < numHashes; i++) {
                int bit = (int) Math.floorMod(h1 + i * h2, (long) numBits);        // double hashing
                long mask = 1L << (bit & 63);
                long before = words.getAndAccumulate(bit >>> 6, mask, (cur, m) -> cur | m);  // atomic
OR (CAS loop)
                if ((before & mask) == 0) changed = true;
            }
            return changed;
        }
        // ... mightContain(): same k positions; any bit == 0 -> return false (definitely absent)
        // ... fnv1a64 (FNV-1a) and fmix64 (MurmurHash3 finalizer) mix the bits
```

Output: `m=766805 bits (93 KiB), k=7`; after an 8-thread insert, `false negatives: 0` and a measured false-positive rate of `1.01%` (target 1%).

Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/bloomfilter/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

A plain `|=` can lose bits (false negatives); atomic OR retries. Bits are **monotonic** (no ABA, no locks) and OR is commutative, so the result is interleaving-independent.

Pitfalls

Non-atomic bit setting; weak hashes (clustered bits); far more than *n* items; negative indices (use `Math.floorMod`).

Real-world examples

Cassandra, HBase, RocksDB (skip disk reads); Guava `BloomFilter`; RedisBloom; "URL already crawled?" checks.

In the interview

30-second answer: "A bit array of size m with k hash positions per item from double hashing; add sets k bits, query checks them — any zero means definitely absent. For concurrency I store bits in an AtomicLongArray and set them with an atomic OR; since bits only go from 0 to 1, reads need no lock. m and k come from n and the target false-positive rate."

Self-check

- **Q:** Bits per element for 1% FPR? **A:** About 9.6.

TL;DR

Bits + k hashes; "no" is certain, "yes" is probable. `AtomicLongArray` + atomic OR = lock-free and correct.

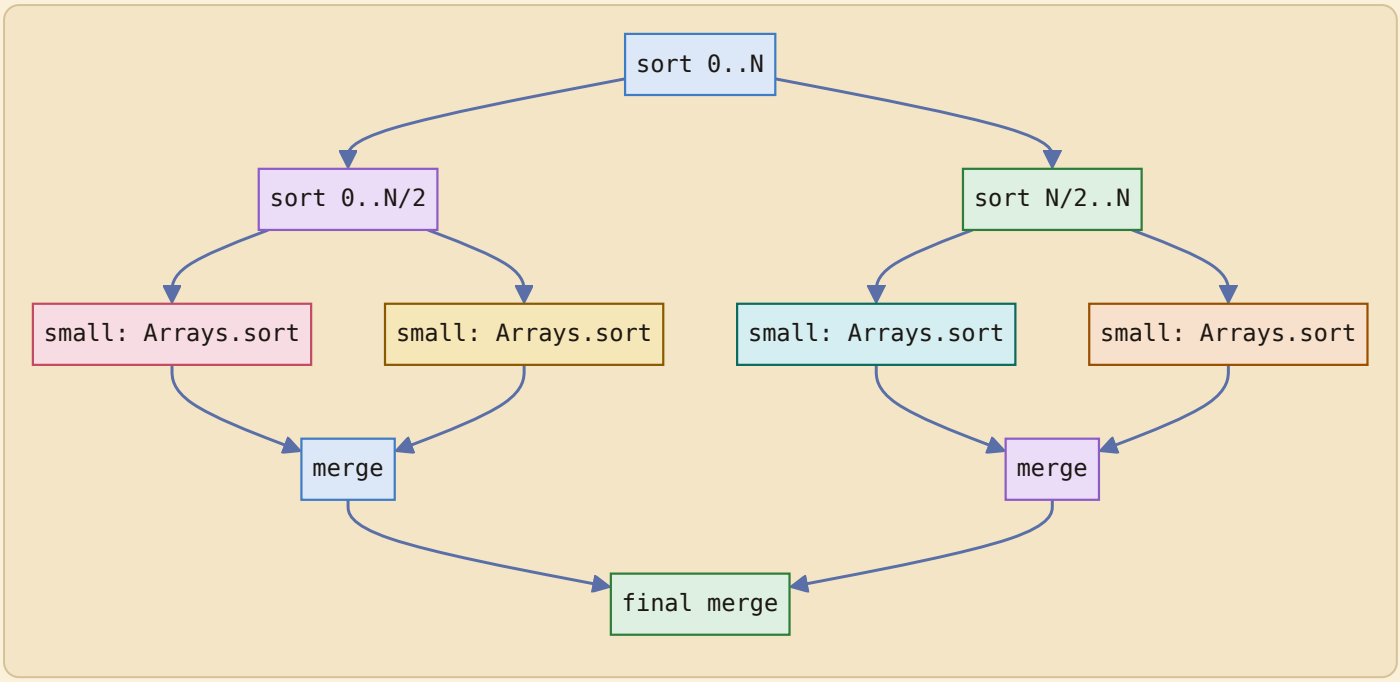
13.10 Multi-threaded Merge Sort (Fork/Join)

Problem

Sort a large `int[]` using all CPU cores.

Approach

Merge sort is **divide and conquer**; Java's **Fork/Join** (`ForkJoinPool`, `RecursiveAction`/`RecursiveTask`) fits it: ranges ≤ 8,192 → `Arrays.sort` sequentially; otherwise split at `(lo + hi) >>> 1` and `invokeAll(left, right)`; merge with **one shared scratch buffer** (tasks use disjoint `[lo, hi)` slices). **Work stealing:** idle pool threads steal tasks from the other end of busy threads' deques.



Java solution

```
// File: code/lld/ch13/mergesort/Main.java
    static final class ParallelMergeSort extends RecursiveAction {
        private static final long serialVersionUID = 1L;
        static final int THRESHOLD = 1 << 13;   // below ~8K elements, splitting costs more than it
saves
        private final int[] a, buf;             // buf = one shared scratch array; tasks use disjoint
ranges
        private final int lo, hi;               // sorts a[lo, hi)

        ParallelMergeSort(int[] a, int[] buf, int lo, int hi) { this.a = a; this.buf = buf; this.lo =
lo; this.hi = hi; }

        @Override protected void compute() {
            if (hi - lo <= THRESHOLD) {
                Arrays.sort(a, lo, hi);                          // sequential base case
                return;
            }
            int mid = (lo + hi) >>> 1;                           // overflow-safe midpoint
            invokeAll(new ParallelMergeSort(a, buf, lo, mid),    // fork both halves, wait for both
                      new ParallelMergeSort(a, buf, mid, hi));
            merge(mid);
        }

        private void merge(int mid) {
            if (a[mid - 1] <= a[mid]) return;                    // already in order: skip
            System.arraycopy(a, lo, buf, lo, hi - lo);
            int i = lo, j = mid, k = lo;
            while (i < mid && j < hi) a[k++] = buf[i] <= buf[j] ? buf[i++] : buf[j++];   // <= keeps
it stable
            while (i < mid) a[k++] = buf[i++];
            // right-half leftovers are already in place
        }
    }

    static void parallelSort(int[] a) {
        ForkJoinPool.commonPool().invoke(new ParallelMergeSort(a, new int[a.length], 0, a.length));
    }
```

Output: `4000000 random ints: matches Arrays.sort = true`, `Arrays.parallelSort agrees = true`. Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/mergesort/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

Disjoint ranges → no races; `invokeAll`'s join gives happens-before for the merge; `<=` keeps it **stable**.

Pitfalls

No threshold; a new buffer per merge; blocking I/O in Fork/Join tasks; `(lo + hi) / 2` overflow; expecting speed-up on tiny arrays (Amdahl).

Real-world examples

`Arrays.parallelSort`; parallel streams; Hadoop/Spark sorts across machines.

In the interview

30-second answer: "A RecursiveAction splits the range in half until it's below a threshold, sorts small pieces sequentially, then merges using one preallocated buffer. invokeAll runs both

> halves in parallel on the ForkJoinPool, whose work stealing keeps cores busy. Subtasks touch disjoint ranges, so no locks are needed."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why is a shared `buf` safe? **A:** Concurrent tasks use non-overlapping ranges of it.

TL;DR

Split until small, sort sequentially, merge; Fork/Join + work stealing; disjoint ranges = no locks.

13.11 Rate limiter — token bucket (thread-safe)

Problem

Limit API calls per client (user id / API key / IP): bursts up to *B*, sustained rate *R*/s, correct under concurrency.

Approach

Token bucket: holds up to *capacity* tokens (the burst), starts full, refills at *refillRate*/s (never above capacity); each request takes one token or is rejected (HTTP 429). Refill **lazily** from `tokens` and `lastRefill` on each request — no background thread. **"Refill + check + take" must be one atomic step**, else two threads spend the same token: (1) `synchronized tryAcquire()`; (2) **lock-free** — `(tokens, lastRefill)` in one immutable `State` record in an `AtomicReference`, swapped by CAS (12.15's trick). Per client: `computeIfAbsent(clientId, …)` makes exactly one bucket. Time comes from an injected `Ticker`.

Algorithm	Bursts	Memory	Notes
Token bucket	Up to capacity	2 numbers	Most common for APIs
Leaky bucket	Smoothed constant output	Queue	Traffic shaping
Fixed window counter	2× burst at window edges	1 counter	Simplest
Sliding window log	Exact	One timestamp per request	Memory-heavy
Sliding window counter	Approximate, smooth	2 counters	Good compromise

Java solution

```
// File: code/lld/ch13/ratelimiter/Main.java
        public synchronized boolean tryAcquire() {
            long now = ticker.nanos();
            tokens = Math.min(capacity, tokens + (now - lastRefill) * tokensPerNano);   // refill +
acquire are ONE atomic step
            lastRefill = now;
            if (tokens >= 1) { tokens -= 1; return true; }
            return false;
        }
    // ...
    /** Same algorithm, lock-free: the whole state is one immutable record swapped with CAS. */
    static final class LockFreeTokenBucket implements RateLimiter {
        private record State(double tokens, long lastRefill) { }
        // ... capacity, tokensPerNano, ticker
        private final AtomicReference<State> state;
        // ...
        public boolean tryAcquire() {
            while (true) {
                State cur = state.get();
                long now = Math.max(ticker.nanos(), cur.lastRefill());   // never move time backwards
                double refilled = Math.min(capacity, cur.tokens() + (now - cur.lastRefill()) *
tokensPerNano);
                boolean ok = refilled >= 1;
                State next = new State(ok ? refilled - 1 : refilled, now);
                if (state.compareAndSet(cur, next)) return ok;            // lost the race? recompute
and retry
            }
        }
    }

    /** One bucket per client key (user id, API key, IP). computeIfAbsent creates each bucket exactly
once. */
        boolean allow(String clientId) { return buckets.computeIfAbsent(clientId, k ->
factory.get()).tryAcquire(); }
```

Output (both versions, capacity 5, refill 2/s):

```
  t=0.0s  7 requests : YYYYYnn
  t=1.0s  3 requests : YYn
  t=1.25s 1 request  : n  (only 0.5 token so far)
  after 1 idle hour  : allowed 5 of 100 concurrent requests (burst capped at 5)
```

Full runnable code: code/lld/ch13/ratelimiter/ (see the Full Edition).

Why it's correct

The decision is atomic (lock, or snapshot + CAS retry) → each token granted once; tokens clamp to `capacity`; `computeIfAbsent` prevents two buckets per client; `Math.max(..., lastRefill)` stops time going backwards.

Pitfalls

Separate refill/take calls; a thread per bucket; `currentTimeMillis()`; unbounded bucket maps (evict idle ones with 13.6's TTL cache); in-memory limits are per server — use **Redis** + Lua for global limits.

Real-world examples

Stripe (Redis token buckets); API Gateway *rate* + *burst*; Guava `RateLimiter`, Bucket4j; NGINX `limit_req` (leaky bucket).

In the interview

> **30-second answer:** "Token bucket: capacity for bursts, refill rate for the average. I refill lazily from elapsed nanoTime on each request, and make refill-check-take one atomic step — synchronized, or lock-free by CASing an immutable state record. A ConcurrentHashMap gives one bucket per client via computeIfAbsent; across servers I'd move the bucket into Redis with a Lua script."

Self-check

- **Q:** Why one immutable `State` in the lock-free version? **A:** `tokens` and `lastRefill` must change together; one CAS on one reference updates both.

TL;DR

Capacity = burst, rate = average. Lazy refill; refill+take atomic (lock or CAS on immutable state); one bucket per client; Redis for multi-server.

13.12 Chapter summary

Problem	Key primitive	The one invariant to state in the interview
FooBar	2 semaphores	Exactly one permit exists across both
Zero Even Odd	3 semaphores	Zero dispatches; one permit circulates
FizzBuzz	monitor + `notifyAll`	Predicates partition 1..n
H2O	2 semaphores + barrier	≤2 H and ≤1 O per round; slot freed after release
Dining Philosophers	ordered locks / n−1 semaphore	No circular wait
TTL cache	CHM + `compute` + conditional remove	Never return or keep expired data; load once per key
Striped map	lock array	Each bucket belongs to exactly one stripe
Blocking queue	lock + 2 conditions	0 ≤ count ≤ capacity; wait in loops
Bloom filter	atomic OR	Bits only go 0 → 1; no false negatives
Merge sort	Fork/Join	Subtasks touch disjoint ranges
Rate limiter	lock or CAS on immutable state	Refill + take is one atomic step

13.13 Chapter self-check

1. **Q:** In FizzBuzz, what bug appears with `notify()`? **A:** The wrong thread wakes and sleeps again; the right one never wakes → hang.
2. **Q:** In H2O, why release the slot after printing? **A:** So the next molecule can't form until this one has fully left.

3. **Q:** Why must the striped map's stripe depend only on the hash? **A:** So a key's lock doesn't change on resize.
4. **Q:** When is `signal()` safe instead of `signalAll()`? **A:** When each condition queue holds only threads waiting for the same thing and one change enables exactly one waiter.
5. **Q:** How do you make a token bucket global across 10 servers? **A:** Store it in Redis and update it atomically with a Lua script.

13.14 Chapter TL;DR

- **Ordering puzzles** (FooBar, ZeroEvenOdd, H2O): semaphores as batons, barriers for groups; "exactly one permit" invariants.
- **Predicate waiting** (FizzBuzz, blocking queue): lock + `while (!condition) wait/await` + `notifyAll` or targeted `signal`.
- **Multi-lock problems** (philosophers): break circular wait with ordering or limiting.
- **Thread-safe data structures** (cache, map, queue, Bloom filter, rate limiter): immutable entries, atomic compound ops, striping, CAS on immutable state, injected clocks.
- **Parallel algorithms** (merge sort): Fork/Join with thresholds and disjoint data.